

Demand for Labour in Competitive Labour Markets

ECON 300 - Labour Economics

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Learning Objectives

- Understand how firms decide how much labour to employ to produce a given level of output.
- Distinguish **short run** (some inputs fixed) from **long run** (all inputs variable).
- See why labour demand is **downward sloping** with respect to the wage.
- Learn the determinants of the **elasticity of labour demand**.
- Analyze impacts of **free trade**, globalization, offshoring, and ICT on labour demand.
- Compare implications under **perfect competition** vs. **monopoly** in product markets.

- Is there empirical support for downward-sloping labour demand?
- How competitive is Canadian labour globally? How have productivity and wages evolved?
- What is the impact of the Internet and technological change on labour demand?
- How can we use labour demand to assess offshoring/globalization effects on wages and employment?

- **Derived demand:** Demand for labour depends on demand for the goods/services it produces.
- **Short run:** At least one input (e.g., capital) is fixed.
- **Long run:** All inputs are variable; firms can adjust capital and labour.

Objective: Profit maximization.

- Constraints: market structure, product demand, factor prices, production function, time frame.
- Labour demand: desired quantity of labour given the wage or a labour supply schedule faced by the firm.

- Output and labour market structures are **independent**.
- Together they shape wage and employment outcomes via demand and supply interactions.

Production Function and Assumptions

- Two inputs: Labour N and capital K ; output $Q = F(K, N)$.
- In the short run, K is fixed; only N varies.

Profit-Maximization: Rules of Thumb

- **Operate** if total revenue covers total *variable* cost.
- Expand output until $MC = MR$.

Revenue Concepts for Input Decisions

- **TRP** (Total Revenue Product): revenue from employing a given amount of an input.
- **MRP** (Marginal Revenue Product): change in total revenue from a marginal unit of the input.

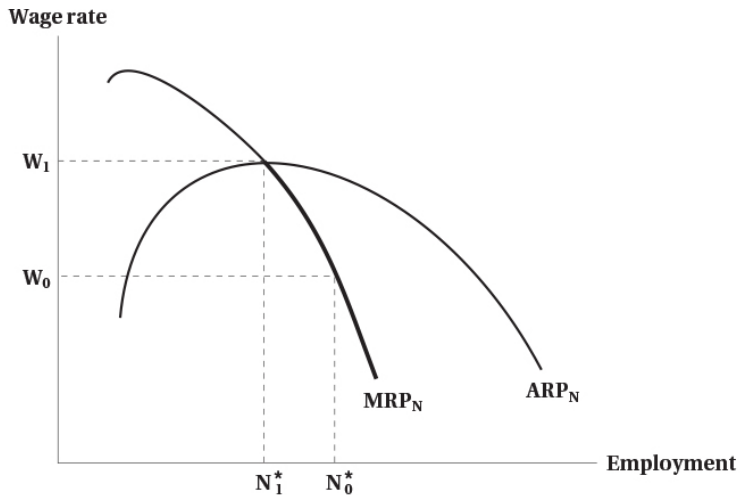
Short-Run Hiring Rule

- Produce if $TRP_N > TC_N$.
- Hire labour until $MRP_N = MC_N = w$.

Competitive Firm: Properties

- Price taker in output and labour markets.
- Can hire labour without affecting the market wage; $MC = AC = w$.
- Hire until $MRP = w$; the **short-run labour demand** is the MRP_N curve.

Figure 5.1: The Firm's Short-Run Demand for Labour

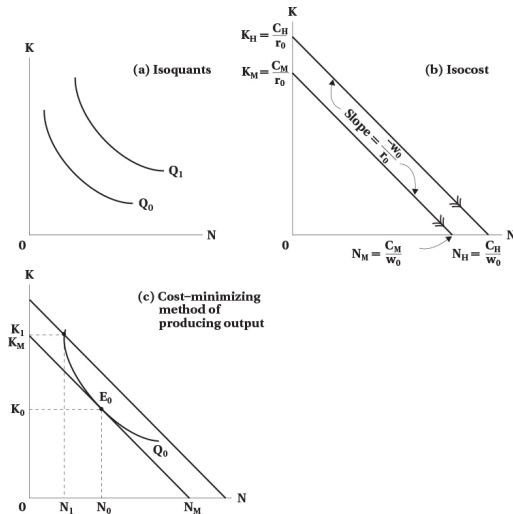


Shutdown Region and Curve Segment

- Shut down if the wage exceeds the **average revenue product** of labour.
- Short-run labour demand coincides with MRP_N *below* the $ARP-MRP$ intersection.
- **Downward sloping:** Diminishing marginal returns; $\downarrow w \Rightarrow \uparrow N$.

- **Isoquant:** Combinations of K and N yielding a given Q ; diminishing MRTS.
 - **MRTS** – the rate at which a firm can substitute labor for capital while keeping production output constant
- **Isocost:** $TC = rK + wN$, all input bundles with the same cost.

Figure 5.2: Isoquants, Isocost, and Cost Minimization



Panel (a): Isoquants

- Curves labeled Q_0 and Q_1 are **isoquants**
- Each isoquant shows all (K, N) combinations producing the same output
- Q_1 represents a higher level of output than Q_0
- Isoquants are:
 - Downward sloping (inputs are substitutes)
 - Convex to the origin (diminishing MRTS)

Isoquants: Interpretation

- Moving **along** an isoquant:
 - Output remains fixed
 - Firm substitutes capital for labour or vice versa
- Moving to a **higher isoquant** (from Q_0 to Q_1):
 - Requires more inputs
 - Represents an increase in output
- Technological change (not shown):
 - Inward shift: productivity improvement
 - Outward shift: productivity decline

Panel (b): Isocost Lines

- Isocosts show combinations of K and N with the same total cost
- Total cost:

$$C = w_0N + r_0K$$

- w_0 : wage rate, r_0 : rental rate of capital
- Lines labeled C_M and C_H represent different cost levels

Isocost Lines: Slopes and Intercepts

- Vertical intercepts:

$$K_M = \frac{C_M}{r_0}, \quad K_H = \frac{C_H}{r_0}$$

- Horizontal intercepts:

$$N_M = \frac{C_M}{w_0}, \quad N_H = \frac{C_H}{w_0}$$

- Slope of the isocost:

$$\text{Slope} = -\frac{w_0}{r_0}$$

- Interpretation: trade-off between labour and capital holding cost fixed

Shifts and Rotations of Isocosts

- Increase in total cost C :
 - Parallel outward shift of the isocost
- Increase in wage w_0 :
 - Isocost becomes steeper
 - Rotates inward around the N -intercept
- Increase in rental rate r_0 :
 - Isocost becomes flatter
 - Rotates inward around the K -intercept

Panel (c): Cost-Minimizing Choice

- Firm wants to produce Q_0 at the lowest possible cost
- Chooses point E_0 where:
 - Isoquant Q_0 is tangent to the lowest isocost
- Optimal input bundle:

$$(K_0, N_0)$$

- Any other point on Q_0 lies on a higher-cost isocost

Tangency Condition at the Optimum

- At the cost-minimizing point E_0 :

$$MRTS_{N,K} = \frac{MPP_N}{MPP_K}$$

- Cost minimization requires:

$$\frac{MPP_N}{MPP_K} = \frac{w_0}{r_0}$$

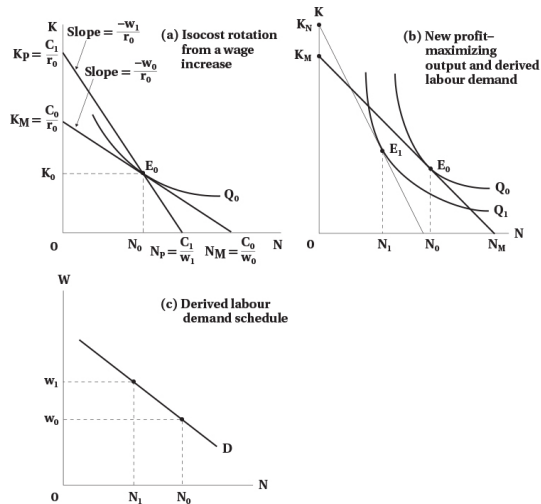
- Interpretation:
 - The rate at which the firm can trade K for N in production
 - Equals the rate at which the market allows substitution via prices

Why Other Points Are Not Optimal

- Points like (K_1, N_1) :
 - Produce Q_0 but lie on higher isocosts
 - Are more expensive than E_0
- Points closer to the origin but not tangent:
 - Either infeasible or violate cost minimization
- Only tangency ensures minimum cost for given output

- **Movement along an isoquant:**
 - Output fixed
 - Input mix changes
 - Driven by changes in relative prices
- **Shift of isoquants:**
 - Caused by technological change
 - Affects productivity and labour demand
- **Rotation of isocosts:**
 - Caused by changes in w_0 or r_0
 - Drives substitution between labour and capital

Figure 5.3: Deriving the Labour Demand Schedule



Cost Increases Under Perfect Competition

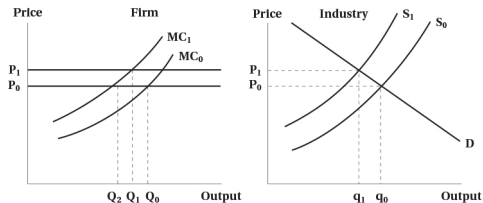
- Higher w rotates the isocost inward; substitute K for N .
- Firm MC and AC shift up; industry output falls and price rises.

Monopoly Case: Cost Increases

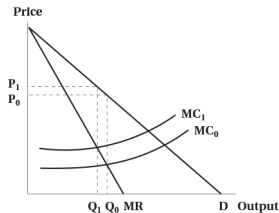
- Monopolist: $MR = MC$, price setter, $P > MC$.
- Hiring more labour lowers both MPP and MR; output and employment responses differ from competition.

Figure 5.4: The Effect of a Cost Increase on Output

(a) Perfect competition



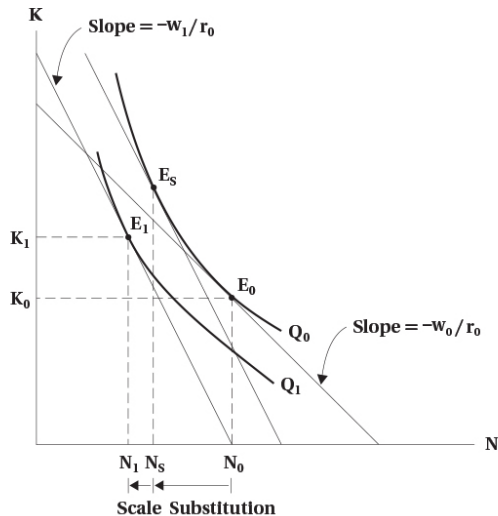
(b) Monopoly



Substitution vs. Scale Effects

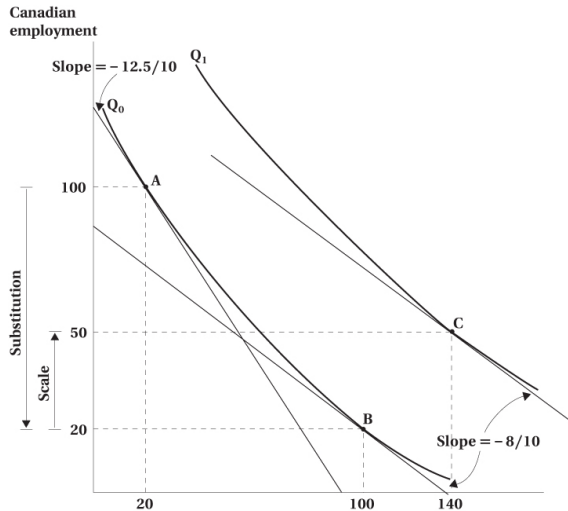
- **Substitution effect:** Use cheaper inputs instead of labour.
- **Scale effect:** Higher costs shrink output scale, reducing all inputs.

Figure 5.5: Substitution and Scale Effects of a Wage Change



Worked Example: Offshoring (Toy Inc.)

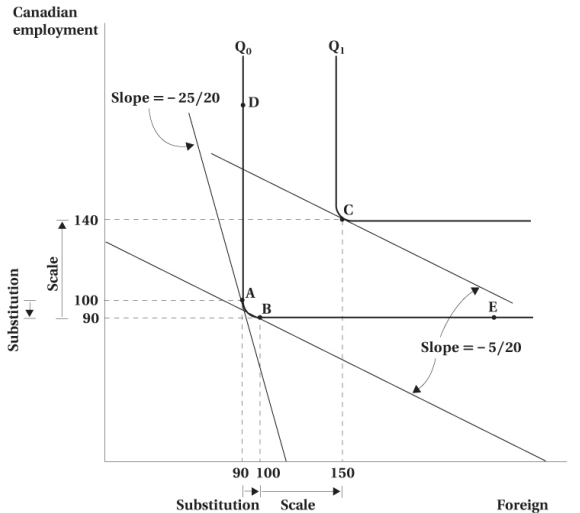
Toy Inc. can hire assembly workers in Canada or abroad; workers are **close substitutes**. Outsourcing abroad $\Rightarrow$ lower effective wage for that task $\Rightarrow$ **reduces Canadian employment**.



Worked Example: Offshoring (Bridge Inc.)

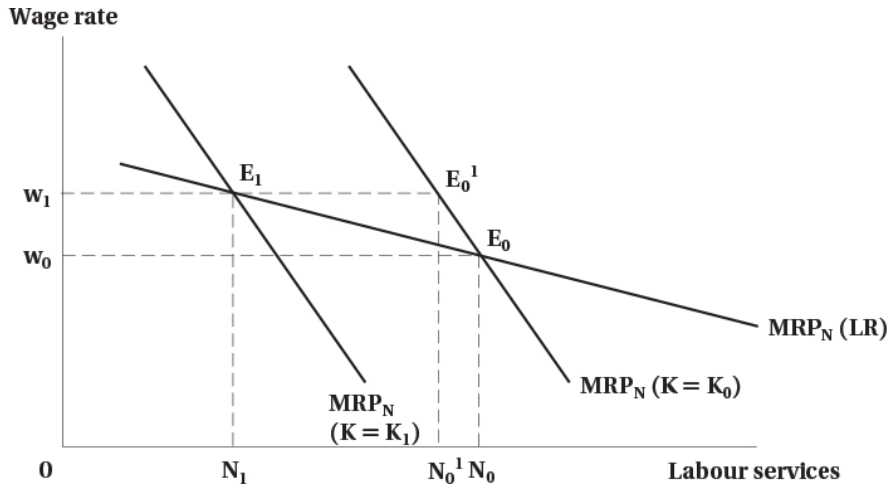
Bridge Inc. builds bridges; Canadian engineers/designers/managers work at home; construction workers hired abroad. Inputs are **complements**. Outsourcing on-site construction **does not reduce** Canadian employment of complementary skilled workers.

Bridge Inc. — Illustration



- **Short run:** K fixed; no substitution effect.
- **Long run:** K variable; substitution $\Rightarrow$ larger employment response to wage changes.

Figure 5.6: Labour Demand in Short vs. Long Run

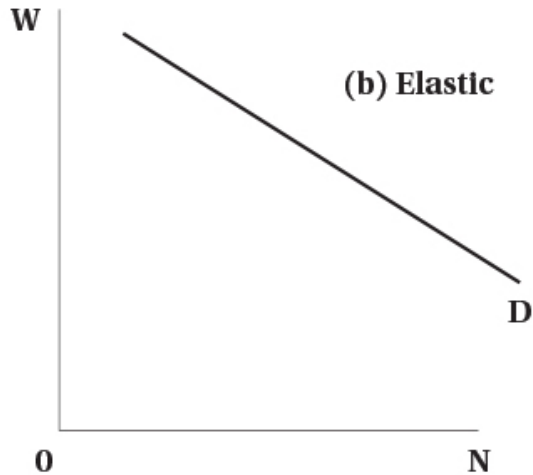
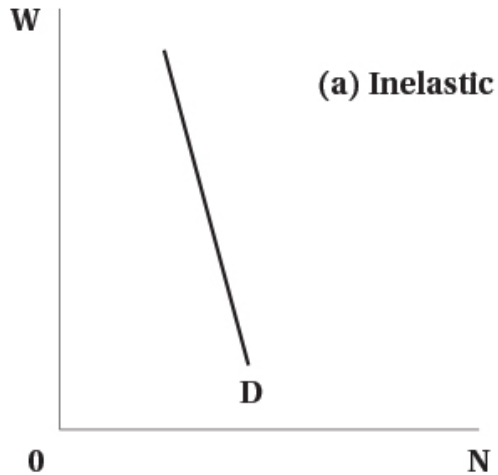


Organizations target **given output at minimum cost**. Scale vs. substitution effects remain key to labour demand responses.

Definition and Measurement

- Demand for labour typically falls when wages rise.
- Elasticity $\varepsilon_{N,w} = \frac{\% \Delta N}{\% \Delta w}$.

Figure 5.7: Inelastic vs. Elastic Labour Demand



Determinants of Elasticity

- Availability of **substitute inputs**.
- Supply conditions of substitute inputs.
- Elasticity of demand for **output**.
- Ratio of **labour cost** to **total cost**.

- Poor substitutability $\Rightarrow$ inelastic labour demand.
- Inelastic product demand $\Rightarrow$ inelastic labour demand.
- Small labour-cost share $\Rightarrow$ inelastic labour demand.

Changing Demand Conditions

- TPP and other trade agreements.
- Offshoring and ICT diffusion.
- Media narratives vs. measured employment impacts.

The Impact of Trade in a Single Labour Market

- Production does not automatically move to lower-wage countries.
- Profit-maximization depends on **both** costs and productivity.
- Foreign and Canadian labour may be **imperfect substitutes**.

TABLE 5.1: Productivity (2000) and Changes in Productivity, Hourly Compensation, and Unit Labour Costs, 2000–2018

Country	Productivity in 2000 (as % of Canada)	% Change in Productivity	% Change in Compensation
Korea	45	99	32
Mexico	46	2	–44
New Zealand	79	21	76
Japan	87	20	–38
Australia	99	24	45
Canada	100	18	16
Spain	102	17	18
United Kingdom	111	18	–5
Finland	116	20	24
Italy	119	1	14
Sweden	121	28	17
United States	123	30	2
Germany	126	19	9
France	129	18	19
Netherlands	135	15	19
Denmark	135	22	33
Switzerland	136	19	40
Belgium	143	14	21
Norway	164	16	46

Figure 5.8: Relative Trends in Labour Costs and Productivity (Canada vs. U.S.)



- **Derived demand:** Labour demand stems from product demand.
- **Short run:** Hire to $MRP = w$.
- **Long run:** Substitution and scale effects; demand more elastic.
- **Elasticity drivers:** Substitutability, output demand elasticity, labour-cost share.
- **Globalization/ICT:** Channels run via productivity, costs, and task (substitute vs. complement).

Thank You!